Surveillance and trust[1]

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The social response of one individual to another is obviously determined, in part, by his perceptions and evaluations of that other. A particularly important aspect of these perceptions is the nature of inferences made by the perceiver about the locus of phenomenal causality for the various motives and behaviors of the other. What Heider (2) has termed the "causal unit," which the perceiver constructs from knowledge of an event and its perceived agent, may be a determinant of his future perception of the agent and/or a function of his previous perception of him. When we attribute, correctly or incorrectly, some "good" deed to a person, this may contribute to our perception of the person himself as "good." If we have prior information which has led to the perception that he is *not* a good person, the causal unit we construct may be quite different: we may suspect some ulterior motive, suppose that he was forced to perform the good act, or we may not construct the unit at all (deny that he performed the act).

This process of causal attribution usually involves some inference about the motivation of the other person (perhaps as to its locus, and perhaps about its nature), and our interaction with or evaluation of the other person may vary in predictable ways along with the type of "causality" attributed. Both Heider and Simmel (3) and Michotte (4) have demonstrated how the perceiving subject imputes causality to the movements and collisions of geometrical objects in the visual field, and the former writers clearly indicated how the attribution of causality for such mechanical events influences the interpretations of the events themselves. Studies by Thibaut, Coules, and Robinson (described in 5) and Thibaut and Riecken (6), although not explicitly concerned with the perception of social

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causality, suggest that this causal attribution process is central to persons' evaluations of one another In another experiment (**7**), Thibaut and Riecken demonstrated that the individual's perception of the causal locus of another's behavior (whether the "cause" of the observed behavior was perceived as "internal" to or "external" to this other person) was a function of the individual's perception of the other's status vis-a-vis himself They also showed that the individual's acceptance of the other person was a function of the perception of causal locus

These studies had a common methodological characteristic an interaction situation was contrived whereby it was possible to assess the ways in which the *S*'s perceptions of other attributes varied as a function of his perception of causality for the events occurring in the situation The present study differs from these in that it concerns, in addition, the role of interaction behavior in *giving rise to* causal attributions, which in turn have consequences for subsequent evaluation and interaction

An ideal situation on which to focus such an investigation is the supervisory situation and what might be termed the "dilemma of the supervisor" The supervisor, who presumably is concerned with the degree to which his subordinates will work without constant supervision, may become victimized by his own previous supervisory behavior If his interactions with the subordinates have been largely confined to frequent monitoring of the subordinates' work efforts (and this may be an accidental by-product of the particular supervisory position), then the supervisor has, in effect, denied himself the opportunity to obtain relevant information concerning their unsupervised work efforts His inferences about the motivation of the subordinates will be shaped by the mode and frequency of his past interaction with them, and he will tend to perceive the causal locus for the work efforts of his subordinates as being "outside" them—perhaps in his own application of power Such an inference will obviously have consequences for his future interaction with them, and something like a self-perpetuating information loss may be the result

The present study employed a simulated supervisory situation Before the method of the experiment is described, a nonoperational statement of the hypotheses will be developed and derived as follows

1 If an individual has high power vis-a-vis a subordinate, and
2 he initiates an influence attempt on this subordinate (in terms of demanding some strenuous productive effort) and
3 has reason to suspect that the subordinate would like to resist this influence attempt, then,
4 if this individual has a high degree of surveillance over the subordinate, and
5 he perceives compliance on the part of the subordinate,
6 he can actually have relatively little information about the loyalty, reliability, or trustworthiness of the subordinate, and
7 he will locate causality for the compliance external to this subordinate

This inference of "external causality," if made, should have some consequences for the individual's future behavior If he enters a new situation where his own goal is the same but where something in the situation limits his freedom to apply his power continuously and comprehensively, he will

1 trust his subordinate less than he would had he perceived the compliance as stemming from some cause lying within the subordinate himself, and
2 make greater efforts to keep him under surveillance (had he made this alternative location of causality)

The conditions for testing the hypotheses in this supervisory relationship were carefully built into the procedure, as indicated below

METHOD

Subjects

*S*s were 40 male students at the University of North Carolina, drawn from undergraduate classes in psychology, sociology, and business administration

Procedure

Part I After being introduced to *E* by the office secretary, *S* was brought into the small-group laboratory where *E* explained the experimental set-up to him *S* was told that he would take part in an experiment on supervision, the desk locations of two prospective subordinates were pointed out to him, and a brief rationale, to be repeated in the formal instructions, was given as to why *S* was to be segregated from his subordinates

S was then led into the observation room behind a one-way vision screen (purposely curtained for this experiment) where *E* instructed him in the operation of the sound system, tape recorder, and signal light *E* next read the initial instructions to *S*. *S* was told that the experimental session would be divided into two parts of 10 work periods each He was informed that his subordinates would be working on a dull task, doing a series of monotonous arithmetic problems, and that he was to attempt to get from them a high output rate on this task *S*'s record-keeping activity was explained to him, and he was then informed of his opportunity to win either $10 00 or

$5 00, this opportunity being contingent upon his managing to keep the output rate of his subordinates as high in the second half of the experiment as in the first At this point the differential monitoring schedule was explained to *S* He was informed that he would have greater surveillance over A than B during Part I, he would monitor A after work periods 1, 2, 3, 4, 6, 7, 8, 9, and 10, he would monitor B after work periods 5 and 10 *S* was told that he could fine 10c of a possible $1 00 wage of a subordinate whenever he caught him falling below a standard output rate which he would set Thus, he could fine A more often than B, since he would monitor A more frequently

When these instructions had been read, *E* left the room, ostensibly to bring the two subordinates into the laboratory Actually there were no real subordinates *S*'s presumption of their presence was created via a series of subterfuges After an appropriate interval *E* rapped upon the one-way screen, thereby signaling that *S* should read instructions to his "subordinates"

With these instructions *S* gave his subordinates essentially the same information that he had learned from *E* He explained the monitoring schedule and his privilege to fine his subordinates for noncompliance with the output standard which he would set He requested that they work hard and informed them that he would fine them, if necessary, to ensure their efforts This procedure was followed for two reasons first, by having *S* read these instructions it was possible to minimize the probability that he might suspect that there were no subordinates, second, in reading these aloud *S* thereby learned more completely the details of the experiment

E next returned to the observation room and instructed *S* to turn on the signal light and start the tape recorder on which was recorded a series of buzzes These buzzes, being played over the sound system, served to designate to *S* and to the two fictitious subordinates the beginning and the end of each alternate work and rest period, both of thirty-second duration After the taped buzzer had sounded twice, indicating the beginning and end of the initial (practice) period, *S* stopped the tape while *E* went into the laboratory to get the production report slips for that period All *S*s perceived from the production report slips, which *E* had prepared before the experimental session, that each subordinate had completed four examples in the practice period *S* recorded the output of each subordinate and then, upon instructions from *E*, notified them of the minimum number of examples he would accept as sufficient work during the succeeding work periods Each subordinate was required to do at least five in each of the work periods to follow He also reminded them of his ability to fine them for their not working and summarized the directions for their activity

At this point *S* started the taped series of work and rest signals and the next ten work periods followed without interruption *E* left the observation room after each work period to get the production report slips whereby *S* might monitor his subordinates in accordance with the monitoring schedule which *S* described in his opening instructions to them At the termination of Work Period 10, *E* returned to *S* all of the production report slips for the nonmonitored periods along with the problem sheets upon which the fictitious subordinates had supposedly determined their answers Table 1 contains the output figures which made up *S's* completed record for each subordinate

TABLE 1

PERIOD-BY-PERIOD OUTPUT OF EACH SUBORDINATE DURING PART I

Subordinate Work Period	GROUP I		GROUP II	
	A	B	A	B
1	5[a]	5	5[a]	5
2	5[a]	5	5[a]	5
3	5[a]	5	5[a]	3
4	6[a]	6	6[a]	6
5	5	5[a]	3	5[a]
6	6[a]	5	6[a]	5
7	5[a]	6	5[a]	6
8	5[a]	5	5[a]	5
9	5[a]	5	5[a]	5
10	5[a]	5[a]	5[a]	5[a]
	52	52	50	50

[a]Indicates subordinate (s) monitored by *S* on that trial

S could easily perceive that the output totals of his two subordinates were equal, despite occasional fluctuations in period-to-period output It may be seen that Group I *S*s never perceived either subordinate as falling below his "standard" of five completed examples per period However, the Group II *S*s perceived that each subordinate fell below this standard once A on trial 5, his only nonmonitored work period and B on trial 3, one of the eight nonmonitored periods Group II was included to ensure condition three of the hypothesis derivation, that *S* have reason to suspect that his subordinate(s) might like to resist his influence attempt

At this point Part I was finished *S* was instructed to turn off the sound equipment after informing his subordinates that they might take a five or ten minute break

Intermission I *S* was now asked to fill out Questionnaire I This series of questions was constructed primarily to yield measures of two variables (*a*) the tendency for S to locate causality for the standard-meeting output of his two subordinates differentially or nondifferentially, (*b*) the trust which *S* held in A and B relative to each other

Part II After *S* had completed Questionnaire I, *E* gave additional instructions, explaining that *S* would have two jobs in Part II he would have to correct the examples which his subordinates had finished in Part I and he would have to keep up their output on similar examples in Part II The use of materials to be utilized in the grading was explained in detail Then *S* was informed that he could monitor whomever he wanted to whenever he wanted to (but never both on the same trial) in his endeavor to keep them working, thereby attaining eligibilty for one of the cash prizes Both these responsibilities were pictured as of equal importance

The work of correcting examples was essential It may be seen that the theory behind the experiment required that there be some limitation on *S*'s ability to apply his power continuously and comprehensively In Part II, the optimal condition for *S* would have been the one in which he could monitor after every work period Although this possibility was theoretically still

open to *S*, it is obvious that it entailed neglect of the important grading task A situation was needed whereby *S* would find it necessary to act upon some inference about the motivation of his subordinates and hope that one or both of them would work hard without constant supervision

E then left the observation room, entered the laboratory, and signaled that *S* should read the new instructions to his workers *S* informed them about his grading task and about his new ability to check on A or B whenever he chose, and he stated that he wanted them to work just as hard as before

When *S* had read these instructions, he again turned on the "no-talking" light and the taped work and rest signals and began correcting the work which he supposed that the subordinates had done during the first series of work periods He sent *E* to monitor a subordinate at his discretion

During work periods 11-20, every production report slip which *E* brought to *S* showed that the subordinates had completed five examples during the period monitored, regardless of identity Thus, no incentive to monitor one subordinate more than the other was offered by anything besides *S*'s own predilections When Work Period 20 had been completed, *E* instructed *S* to cease the correcting work, turn off the sound equipment, and tell his subordinates to take another break

Intermission II Questionnaire II was administered to *S* at this point It was designed primarily to obtain an "after the fact" expression of *S*'s confidence in his two workers and a prediction of what his monitoring behavior *would have been* had he been required to select a subordinate for greater surveillance in Part II When *S* finished answering this questionnaire, he was led into the laboratory and there *E* explained in full the purpose and deceptions involved in the experiment This terminated the experiment

Hypotheses and Results

Before dealing with the specific hypotheses and results, it should be noted that data for Groups I and II were basically quite similar There were no significant differences between the two groups in terms of (*a*) the proportion of *S*s whose statements about the causal loci for their subordinates' compliance could be consistently classified (see discussion of Hypothesis 1-a), (*b*) the proportion of *S*s who made the hypothesized differential causality location, nor (*c*) the proportion of *S*s who monitored A more often than B during Part II There appeared only a slight tendency for these proportions to be greater in Group II than in Group I, and so in presenting certain of the following results the data for Groups I and II have been combined and a third analysis computed The I+II analysis is never included as an alternative for the two for which the original design called, it is intended only as a supplement

Surveillance and Trust

Hypothesis 1 During Part II of the experiment, Ss will monitor subordinate A more often than subordinate B To test this prediction, a t test for the difference between correlated means was used with the number of times a given S monitored B subtracted from the number of times he monitored A as the score unit The results appear in Table 2 This hypothesis appears confirmed

TABLE 2

SIGNIFICANCE OF MEAN DIFFERENCE IN MONITORING ATTEMPTS DIRECTED AT A IN EXCESS OF B

Group	Mean diff Score	SM_d	N	t	p (1-tailed test)
I	55	23	20	2 39	015
II	55	25	20	2 20	021

Hypothesis 2 Ss will attest to a greater trust in subordinate B than subordinate A at the termination of Part I The data pertinent to this hypothesis were obtained from a questionnaire item, in response to which S could state that he held greater trust in B than A, greater trust in A than B, or equal trust in both A and B The frequencies with which the three answers were checked appear in Table 3

TABLE 3

N OF Ss IN EACH GROUP EXHIBITING THE DIFFERENT VARIETIES OF TRUST JUDGMENTS

	Group I	Group II
N Ss trusting A more than B	1	0
N Ss trusting B more than A	10	14
N Ss trusting A and B equally	9	6

Those ties (Ss who did not discriminate between A and B on this trust dimension) were split between the other two categories, one-half the N in the A = B category was added to the N in the A > B category and the other half to the B > A category The exact binomial probabilities of obtaining breaks as great as those which resulted were found to be 039 for the Group I and less than 001 for Group II This hypothesis appears confirmed.

Surveillance and Trust as a Function of Perception of Causal Locus

Hypothesis 1-a The differential monitoring predicted in Hypothesis 1 will be a function of S's locating causality for A's compliance outside A and for B's compliance inside B Here it was necessary to determine the relationship between *S*'s perception of the causal locus for the compliance of A and B and his surveillance over (monitoring of) them The first six *S*s in each group were given an objective multiple-choice question to tap this perception This question was discarded since it was apparently not appropriate to the *S*'s own phenomenology and therefore yielded practically no range of scores *S*s' own statements about "the reasons for A's (B's) successfully meeting the output minimum" consistently differed in content from the statements originally offered in the objective form of the question For this reason, the remaining 28 *S*s answered an open-ended rather than the multiple choice item

Preliminary inspection of the responses to this question indicated that they could be sorted into four categories, exemplified as follows

Causality *internal* to subordinate e g , "The feeling of doing a good job with or without supervisory attention Knowing what his output minimum was would set for him a goal to work for "

Causality *external* to subordinate e g , "Pressure of being checked and possible desire to keep from being fined "

Causality *both internal and external* to subordinate e g , "I think he might have been considering the 10 cent fine, but, more likely, an element of competition enters here "

Noncategorizable statements e g , "He worked consistently and did not have too high a minimum "

Seven judges were employed in sorting the statements One of them was *E,* and the other six were faculty members or graduate students in sociology or psychology For any *S* to be used in the analyses employing the location-of-causality statements, at least five of the seven judges had to agree on the best category for a *S*'s statements about *both* A and B In no case did any of the judges know how *S* had monitored his subordinates

With this type of content classification, the following breakdowns were considered as *differential* causal location and consistent with the hypothesized categories of causality *external* to A as opposed to *internal* to B·

Locus for Subordinate A	Locus for Subordinate B
external	internal
external + internal	internal
external	internal + external
external	noncategorizable[2]

Group I yielded eight *S*s whose causality statements implied either a differential location of causality in terms of the above classification or a nondifferential location, and Group II yielded eleven such *S*s out of a possible fourteen for each group The relationship between monitoring and causality location was calculated for each group and for the data of the combined groups using Fisher's method for computing exact probabilities The causality dimension was dichotomized into nondifferential vs differential location of one of the above four types It should be noted here that no *S* located causality in a way that might be construed as internal for A and external for B That is, a causal location the reverse of that hypothesized never appeared Thus, the differential category is not misleading—it always indicates a differential location consistent with the hypothesized classification in its modified form This made it possible to dichotomize the surveillance dimension into "monitor A more than B" *vs* "other" The trends which appeared were in the hypothesized direction The probabilities are shown in Table 4

TABLE 4

EXACT PROBABILITIES COMPUTED FOR RELATIONSHIP BETWEEN CAUSALITY LOCATION AND SURVEILLANCE (MONITORING)

Group	*N*	*p*
I	8	107
II	11	197
I+II	19	015

One may not accept the hypothesis in its original statement as conclusively supported However, there is certainly an indication

[2] This classification was accepted as differential causality location for one *S* only The statement was "Practice until 5 and 10 in order to meet the required minimum" *E* was the only judge who knew that *S* meant that the subordinate (B) was practicing on his nonmonitored work periods so that he might succeed on the work periods when he was monitored (5 and 10) It was *E's* decision, with the concurrence of the judges available at the time of the analysis, that this statement implied a locus of causality internal to the subordinate and that it could justifiably be used in the analysis

that the tendency to monitor A more than B is a function of *S*s' locating causality for compliance internal to B as opposed to external to A

Hypothesis 2-a The differential trust predicted in Hypothesis 2 will be a function of S's locating causality for A's compliance outside A and for B's compliance inside B An analysis similar to that used with Hypothesis 1-a was employed here The causality dimension was again dichotomized into differential *vs* nondifferential location, the trust dimension into *"B* more than *A" vs* "other" The exact probabilities appear in Table 5

TABLE 5

EXACT PROBABILITIES CALCULATED FOR TRUST AS A FUNCTION OF DIFFERENTIAL CAUSALITY LOCATION

Group	*N*	*p*
I	8	214
II	11	182
I+II	19	017

As with Hypothesis 1-a, this prediction cannot be viewed as confirmed The data are, however, consistent with those of Hypothesis 1-a, and are certainly indicative of a relationship between *S*s' tendency to trust B more than A and their mode of causality location

Responses of Ss in "forced-choice" situations

It may be observed that the two main dependent variable measures, monitoring behavior and statements about trust, left to *S* the possibility of "equality" judgments—*S* could monitor A and B equally often, and he could attest to equal confidence in his subordinates Two additional hypotheses concerned questionnaire items which required *S* to discriminate between his two subordinates—the only way in which an "equality" judgment could be made was if *S* did not answer the question at all

Hypothesis 3 At the end of Part I, Ss will feel that subordinate B is more dependable than subordinate A The data appear in Table 6

Of the four cases in the "no answer" category of Group I, two were assigned to the "A more dependable" and two to the "B more dependable" categories The exact binomial probabilities of obtain-

TABLE 6

N OF *S*s IN EACH GROUP EXHIBITING THE DIFFERENT VARIETIES OF "DEPENDABILITY" JUDGMENTS

	Group I	Group II
N Ss seeing A as more dependable	0	1
N Ss seeing B as more dependable	16	19
N Ss not answering	4	0

ing proportions of B > A as great as these (18/20 and 19/20) were both less than 001 The hypothesis seems confirmed The effect of forcing *S* to make a discrimination on such a dimension may be observed if one compares the frequencies in Tables 3 and 6 In every instance where *S* stated that he trusted B more than A, he also saw B as more dependable Thus, any increase from "trust" to "dependability" in the frequency of B > A or A > B represents *S*s who would not discriminate when not forced to but who did so when required Only one *S* in Group I who stated greater trust in A than B could not discriminate on dependability

Hypothesis 4 *Ss will state that, had they been forced to select a subordinate for higher surveillance during Part II, they would have chosen subordinate A* The frequencies of different responses to this forced-choice questionnaire item appear in Table 7

TABLE 7

N OF *S*s WHO WOULD SELECT A PARTICULAR SUBORDINATE FOR A MAJORITY OF MONITORING ATTEMPTS IF FORCED TO MAKE SUCH A DISCRIMINATION

	Group I	Group II
N Ss who would monitor A >B	14	15
N Ss who would monitor B >A	3	5
N Ss not answering item	3	0

The three cases in Group I who did not answer the question were, as previously, "split," enlarging the *N* of the other two categories by 1 5 The exact binomial probabilities of obtaining proportions as great as these were found to be 013 for Group I and 032 for Group II This hypothesis appears confirmed The effect of forcing a discrimination upon *S* may be observed by comparing the frequencies of Table 7 with those frequencies obtained in the actual monitoring situation · in Group I, nine *S*s monitored A more

than B, one *S* monitored B more than A, and ten *S*s monitored A and B equally often; in Group II, eleven *S*s monitored A more than B, three *S*s monitored B more than A and six *S*s monitored A and B equally often Each *S* that actually monitored A more than B maintained that he would have monitored thus had he been forced to select a subordinate for greater surveillance In Group I, of the ten *S*s who actually monitored A and B equally often, five said that they would have selected A for a forced majority of monitorings, three said B and two could not answer the question, nor could one *S* who had monitored B more than A In Group II, four of the six *S*s who monitored equally said that, if forced to choose, they would have monitored A more than B The other two would have selected B for closer surveillance

Surveillance Behavior as a Function of S's Confidence in his Subordinates

Hypothesis 5 S's monitoring behavior during Part II will be a function of the relative confidence he holds in his two subordinates The confidence data were obtained from an objective question which *S* had to answer separately for each subordinate He could state that (*a*) he thought he could have confidence in the subordinate at the beginning of Part II, (*b*) he did not think he could have confidence in him ,(*c*) he wasn't sure whether he could have confidence in him or not This confidence variable was dichotomized by having those *S*s who designated more confidence in B than A counted in a *differential confidence* category, all other *S*s being counted in an "other" category These latter *S*s attested to equal confidence (or lack of confidence) in both subordinates, with the single exception of an *S* who stated confidence in A but unsureness about B and monitored his subordinates equally often One *S* in Group II did not answer the question completely and could not be used The

TABLE 8

EXACT PROBABILITIES COMPUTED FOR RELATIONSHIP BETWEEN *S*'S MONITORING BEHAVIOR AND HIS RELATIVE CONFIDENCE IN HIS SUBORDINATES

Group	*N*	*p*
I	20	038
II	19	208
I+II	39	011

surveillance dimension was dichotomized into "monitor A more than B" and "other." The exact probabilities calculated for these resulting fourfold tables appear in Table 8. This hypothesis gained support form the data of Group I and from the combined groups. Although the support given by Group II is not conclusive, the hypothesis is given tentative acceptance.

DISCUSSION

The implications of these results are of dual import: first, as they relate to other findings in the general area of social perception and second, in their suggestions for problems of supervisory practice.

Solomon (5), in an experiment which tested derivations from Deutsch's theory of interpersonal trust and cooperation (1), clearly demonstrated that a person's tendency to trust another was a function of the type of motivation attributed to the other. More specifically, he showed that to the extent that Person I perceived Person II to be benevolently motivated (toward I himself) the more likely would he be to like and trust II. The results of the present study make it possible to carry this conclusion a step farther: only one *S* attributed, in his statements about causality for B's compliance, anything like the benevolent motivation observed by Solomon. Trusting behavior tended to appear when *S* attributed to the subordinate a motivation which was essentially "self-oriented" but which might, as a by-product, result in some profit to *S*.

The results of these two studies indicate that the relationship between motive attribution and interpersonal trust depends crucially upon the situation as it defines the role and meaning of trust. In a variation of Solomon's experiment, Person I's outcomes depended on Person II's behavior from the beginning of interaction, and I's inferences about II's motivation involved the attribution of a benevolent orientation to II. In the present study, where the supervisor-subject's outcomes did not depend on B's (nor A's) behavior until *after* he made the inference about the causal locus for the subordinate's compliance, the attribution of "self-oriented" motivation appeared.

This leads to the suspicion that there may be demonstrated a wider variety of attributed internal causality of which apparent trusting behavior may be a function. For instance, one may trust the Salvation Army worker to see that one's old clothes get to some

recipient among the poor and needy, yet one would probably not think him benevolently oriented toward oneself nor perceive an "orientation-toward-self" on the part of the worker Perception of a benevolent orientation on the part of the worker toward others may prompt the trusting behavior although it may have no personal relevance for the donor

The second important implication derived from the results is one of more immediate practical value a supervisor (or any superordinate) cannot know first-hand the nature of the loyalty of his subordinates until he perceives that they have had an opportunity to be disloyal In this experiment, *S* could perceive that subordinate B had this opportunity, B had been under low surveillance, yet he had apparently worked diligently Subordinate A, on the other hand, had been under high surveillance by *S* and, although his work efforts were essentially identical with those of B, they were more often perceived by *S* as a function of *S*'s own power over him

In actuality, *S*'s inferences about the locus and type of A's motivation and trustworthiness were to a great degree unfounded The only instance when *S* might receive the pertinent information regarding these attributes was the single work period (Trial 5) in Part I when A was not monitored, and it has already been seen that A's output on this trial had litle effect as a determinant of *S*'s behavior toward the subordinate It is questionable whether or not *S* actually had something like an absolute distrust of A or felt that he was really undependable, since he evaluated his subordinates relative to one another The answer to this question must await an experimental variation in which *S* has only high or low surveillance over his subordinates There was some evidence that *S*'s more frequent monitoring of A was a function of his not being sure about having confidence in the subordinate instead of his actually lacking confidence in him, insofar as only one *S* made the latter declaration All other *S*s attested to either confidence in their subordinates or to unsureness about one or both of them

It is submitted that *S*'s inference about the causal locus external to A was based more upon this lack of the appropriate information about A's motivational state than on any conclusive evidence that high surveillance was the real determinant of A's compliance It is obvious that such an inference from incomplete data may occur in a variety of situations where an individual is called upon to judge

some other person(s) on a given trait If the previous interaction context has been such that the individual has not been able (or has neglected) to test the existence in another of a needed characteristic or skill, the individual may be forced to infer that it is not present and so modify his own behavior On the other hand, the individual may need information about another person's possible negative feelings (like hostility or distrust) or malevolent motivation, but he may have kept this person under high surveillance to the extent that there has been no opportunity to display these feelings or motives If manifestation of these motives might threaten his position, he may be forced to infer that they are present and behave accordingly This strongly suggests that the superordinate should give himself the opportunity to appraise the motivational characteristics of his subordinates before he has to govern his behavior on the basis of such an appraisal, moreover, he must be able to locate causality for their behavior accurately before he is in a position to make this appraisal

SUMMARY

An experiment was conducted to investigate an aspect of the role of surveillance in the development of interpersonal trust. does the differential surveillance which a superordinate *S* has over two subordinates result in his holding differential trust in them and in a desire to maintain this differential surveillance? It was predicted that this differential trust and surveillance would be a function of *S*'s perceiving a differential causal locus for the subordinates' compliance with his productivity demands

The experimental situation was one in which the *S*-supervisor demanded from two workers (actually fictitious) a high output on an apparently dull task He had the power to check up on (monitor) and possibly punish these workers for not meeting his output demands, but he had this power to a far greater extent over worker A than worker B during an initial series of 10 work periods After this series of work periods the supervisor could see that the output of both workers (*a*) always met or exceeded his output standard (Group I) or (*b*) failed to meet the output standard on only one nonmonitored work period (Group II) and (*c*) was ultimately equal

The major findings were

1 When free to monitor each subordinate equally during a second series of work periods, the supervisor monitored more the subordinate who was placed under high surveillance during the initial trials

2 *Ss* showed less trust of the more highly surveyed subordinate than of the infrequently surveyed subordinate

3 A strong tendency, albeit not a conclusive one, existed for the differential monitoring and differential trust to be a function of *S*'s perception of differential causal loci for his subordinates' compliance Subjects who monitored A more than B or trusted B more than A tended to perceive A's compliance as due to forces outside A, most often in their own application of power Conversely, they tended to perceive the causal locus for B's compliance as inside B, that is, they saw B's compliance as stemming from some personal desire to do well

4 *Ss* saw the subordinate infrequently surveyed on the initial trials as more dependable than the frequently surveyed subordinate

5 *Ss* testified that, if they had been compelled to select a subordinate for a majority of monitoring attempts during the second series of work periods, they would have chosen the one over whom they had already had higher surveillance, subordinate A

6 The optional differential surveillance which occurred during the second series of work periods appeared to be a function of the differential confidence which *S* held in his subordinates, although the relationship was not conclusive

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